



# Statistical Methods & Machine Learning 1

Class #10

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November 5, 2024

# Outline

- Review
  - Regression assumptions
  - Unusual observations
  - Multiple testing



# Regression assumptions

# OLS Assumptions

Will see these assumptions presented a variety of ways (e.g., some are often combined), but they boil down to the following:

1. There is a linear relationship between the predictor(s)  $X$  and the outcome  $Y$ . – Relatively simple assumption to relax as we will see.
2. Variable,  $X_1, \dots, X_n$ , are fixed constants such that  $S_{XX} > 0$
3. Variable,  $\epsilon_1, \dots, \epsilon_n$ , are random variables
4. Zero Error Mean:  $E(\epsilon_i) = 0$  for  $i = 1, \dots, n$
5. Uncorrelated errors:  $\epsilon_1, \epsilon_2, \dots, \epsilon_n$  are not correlated – i.e., knowing value of  $\epsilon_1$  tells you nothing about  $\epsilon_2, \dots, \epsilon_n$
6. Constant error variance:  $V(\epsilon_i) = \sigma^2$  -- AKA homoscedasticity
7. Error normality:  $\epsilon_i \sim N(0, \sigma^2)$  for  $i = 1, \dots, n$

# OLS Assumptions

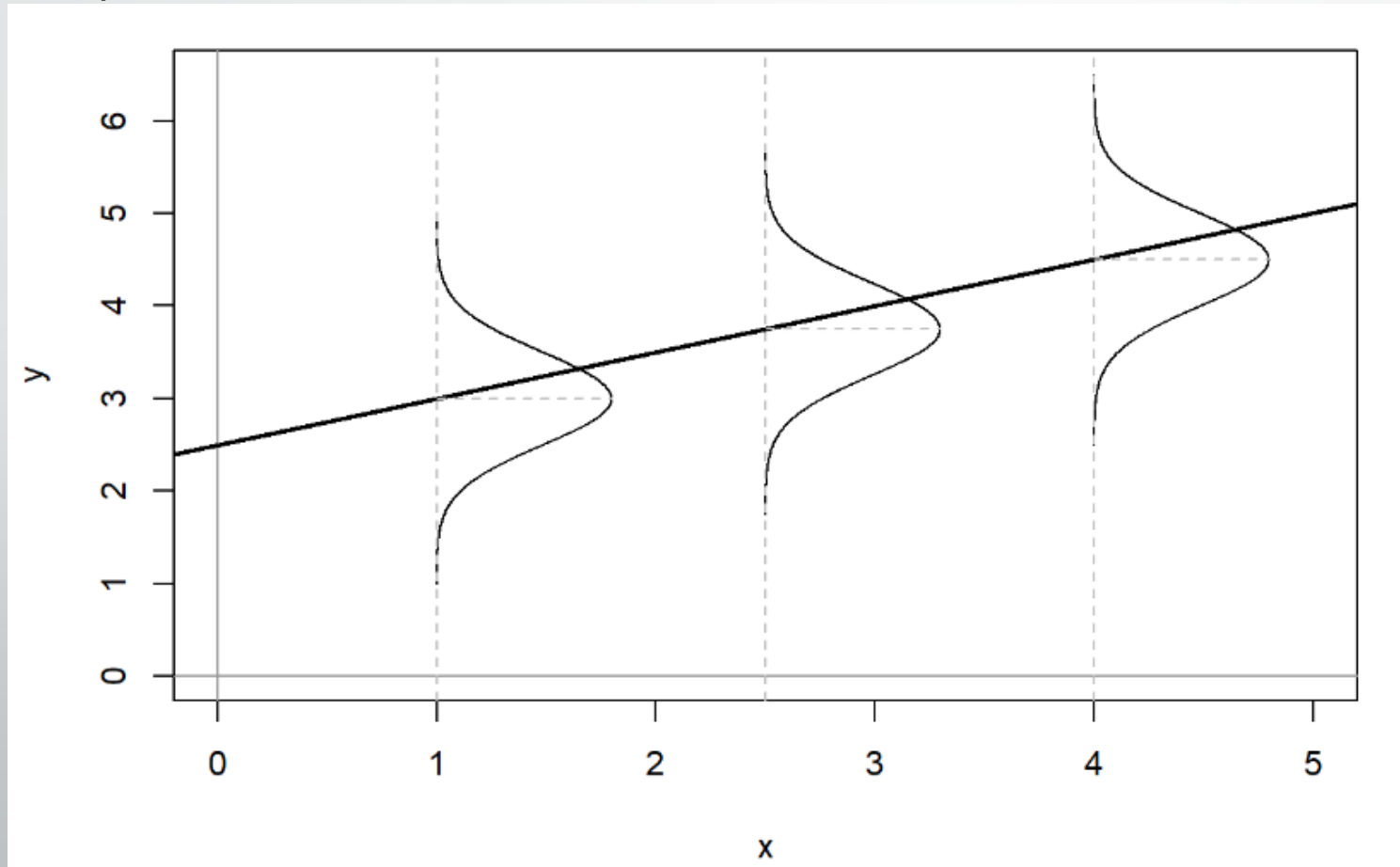
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# OLS Assumptions

Pay particular attention to assumptions 4-7

- Taken together they state that our errors are assumed to be normal, independent, and identically distributed (Normal I.I.D).



Jenkins-Smith, Ripberger, Copeland, et. al.

# Impact of assumption violations

- Dependence of errors can cause problems as it means there is less information in your dataset than sample size would lead you to believe.
  - Think your estimates are more precise than they are.
- Non-constant error variance can cause problems with inaccurate inferences due to poorly quantified precision.
  - Prediction uncertainty particularly susceptible.
- Non-normal errors can also lead to inaccurate inferences, but for larger datasets inferences will be more robust to moderate violations due to the central limit theorem.
- Violation of zero mean error assumption can indicate issues with error dependence, error normality, and/or non constant error variance.

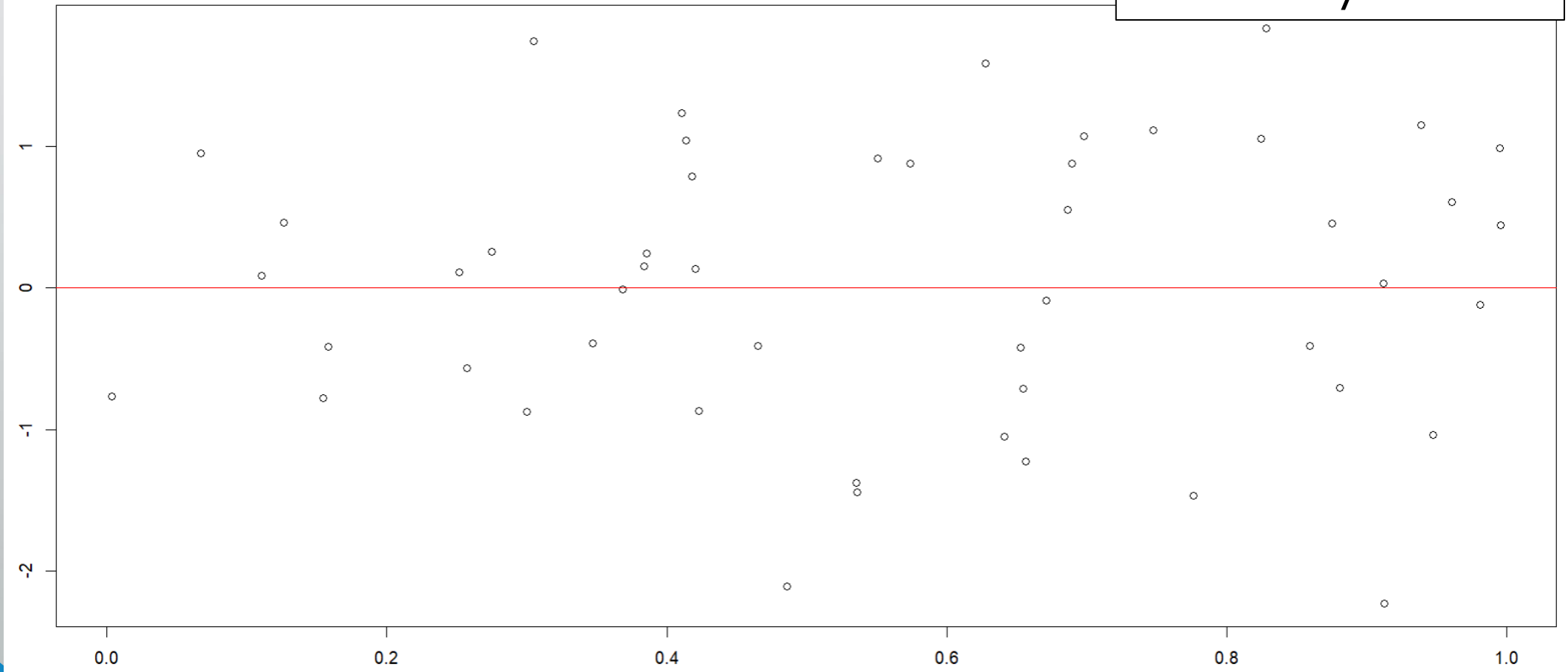
# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity

- Let's look at a few different scenarios to see what these violations might look like graphically.
- To do this we will fit a scatter plot with our fitted values for a given model on the x axis and the residuals from the same model on y axis

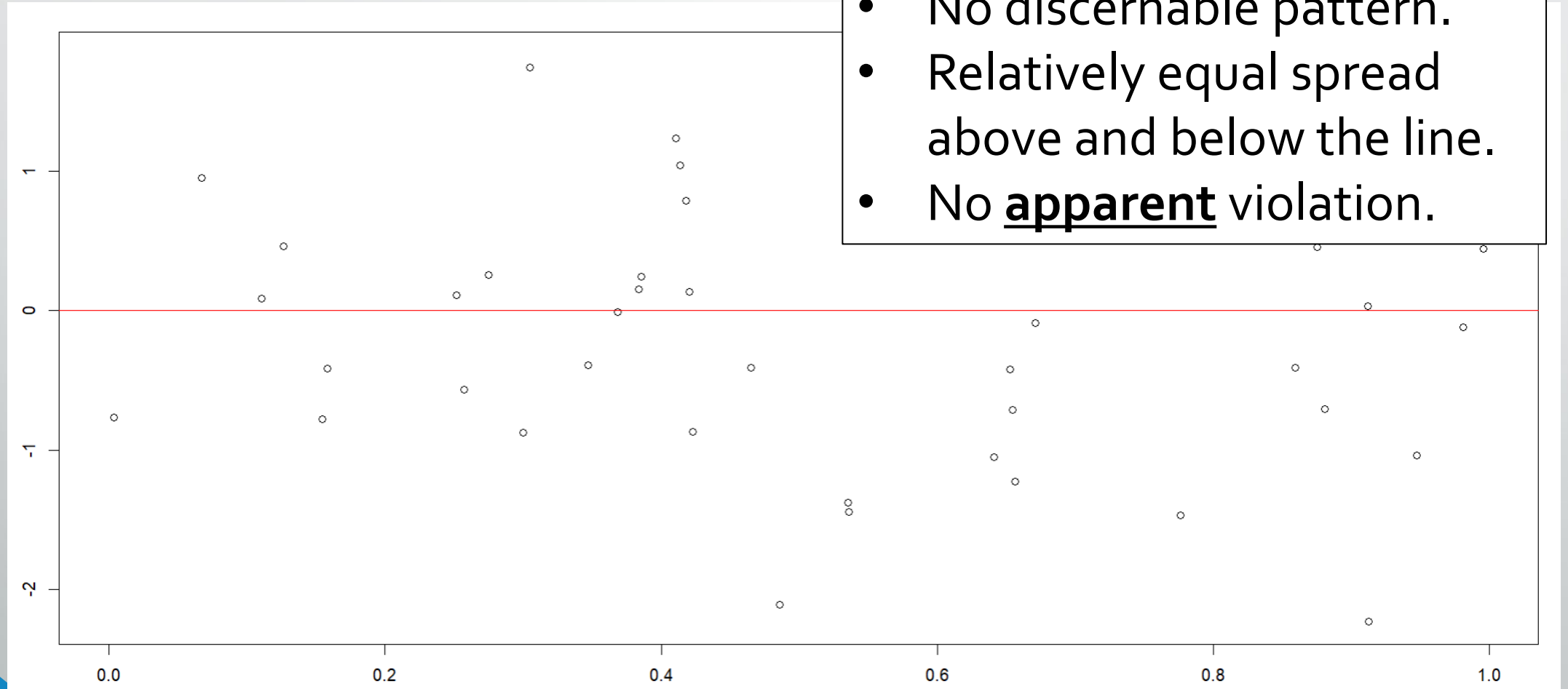


# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity

What do you see?

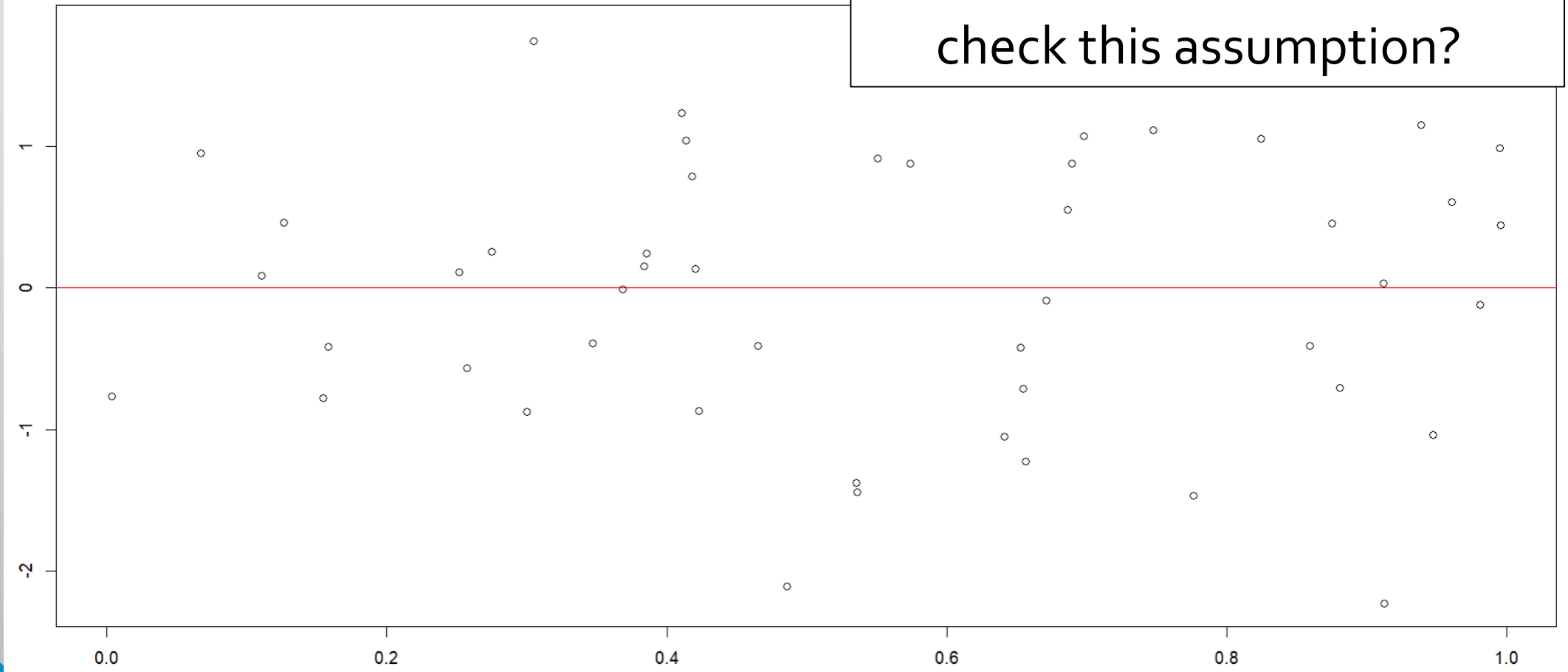


# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity

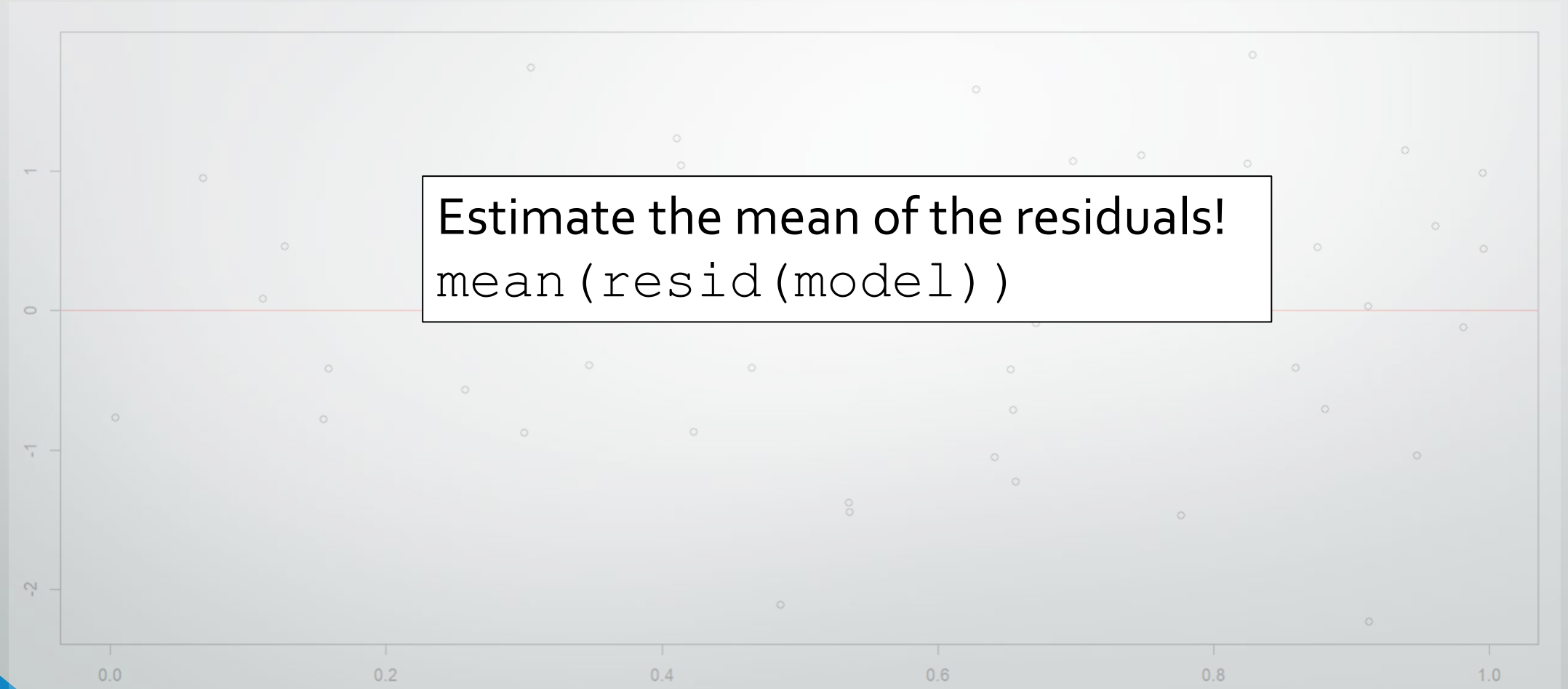


# Zero mean error

- What else should we do to check this assumption?

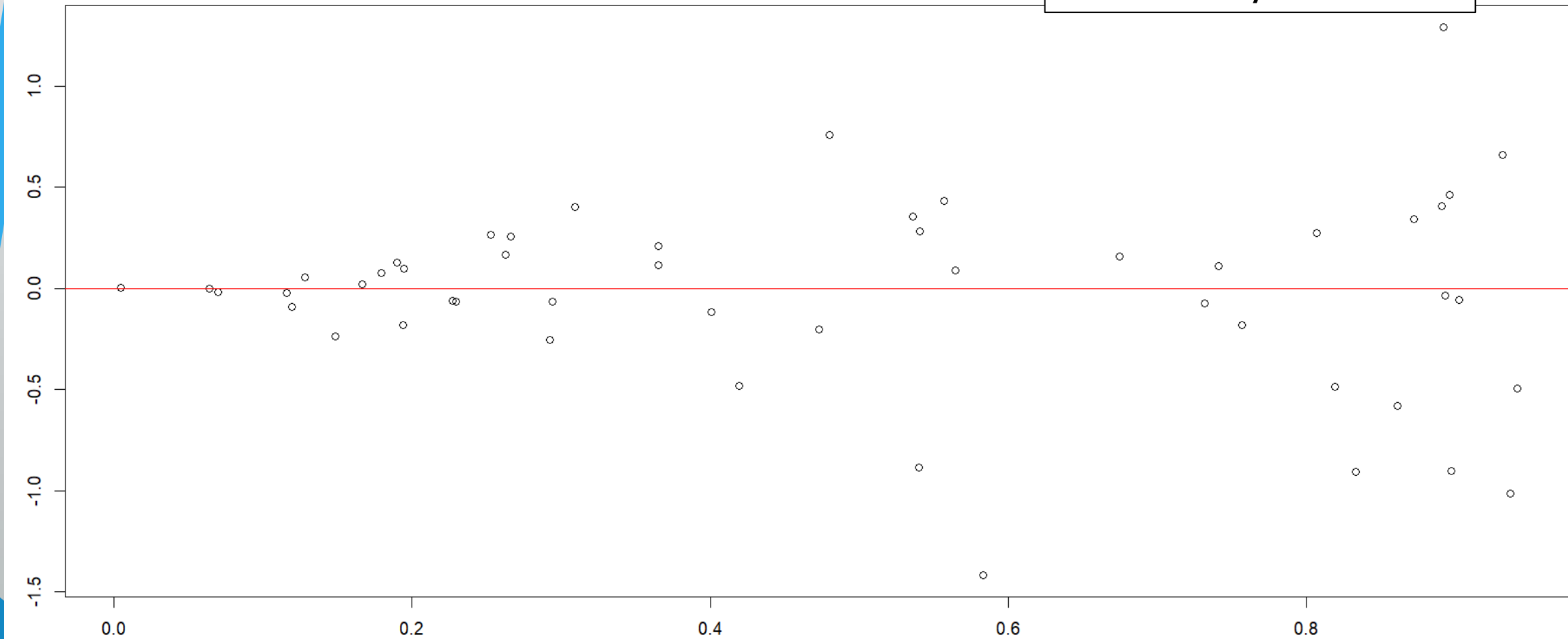


# Zero mean error



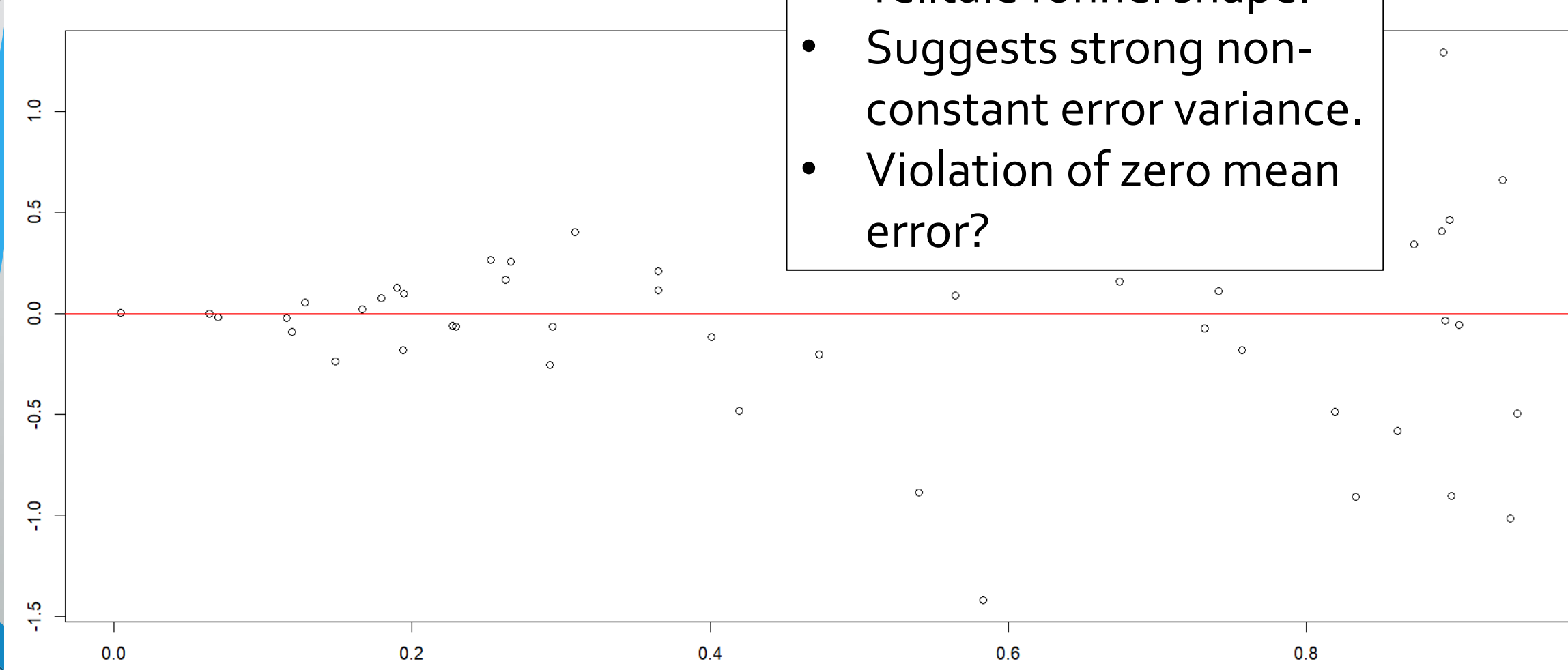
# Zero mean error + Homoscedasticity

What do you see?



# Zero mean error + Homoscedasticity

- Telltale funnel shape.
- Suggests strong non-constant error variance.
- Violation of zero mean error?



# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity

- Telltale funnel shape.
- Suggests strong non-constant error variance.
- Violation of zero mean error – **harder to say.**



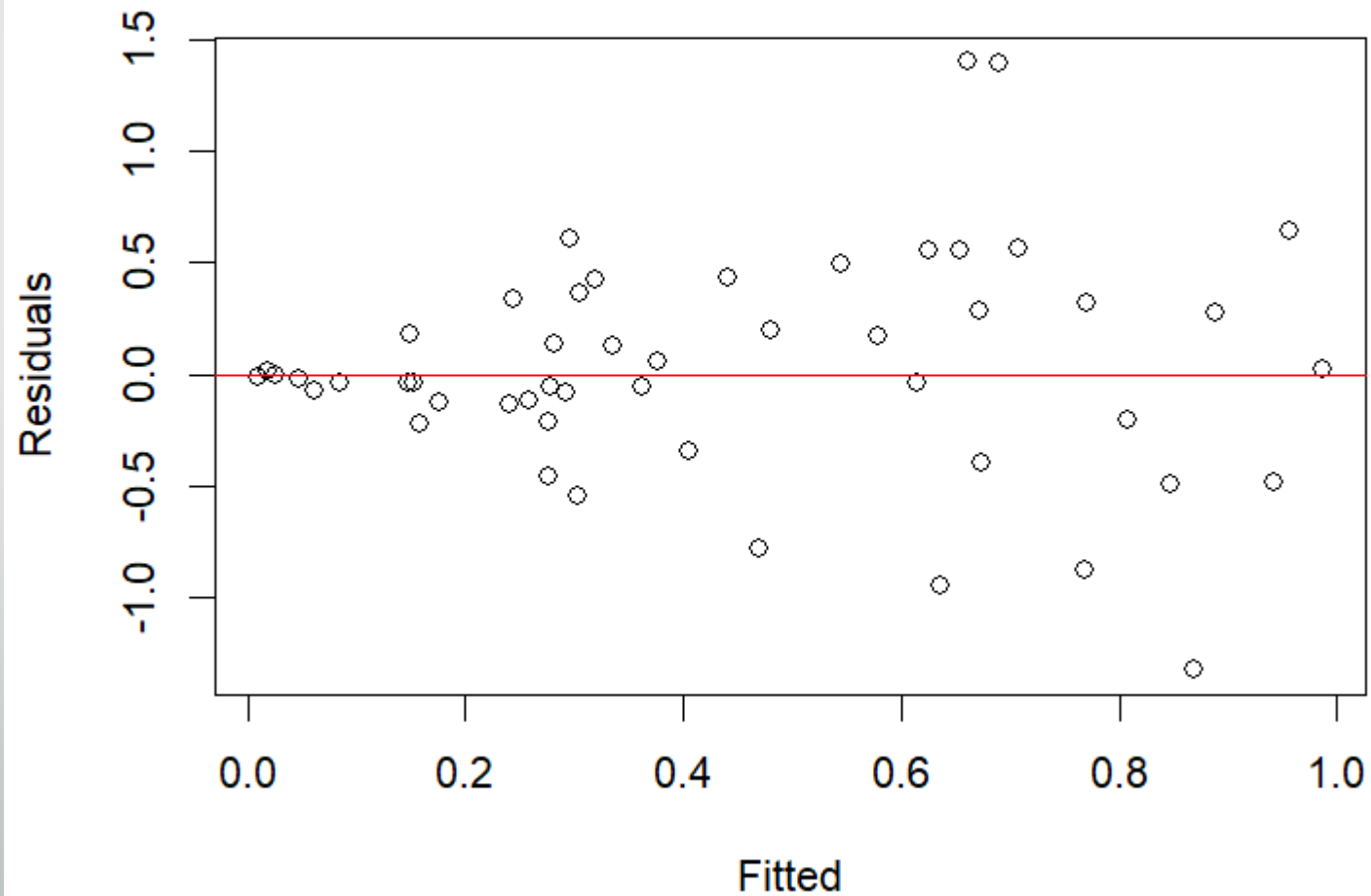
# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity

- Let's look at another example.
- This time we'll assess the zero mean error and homoscedasticity assumptions both graphically and numerically.



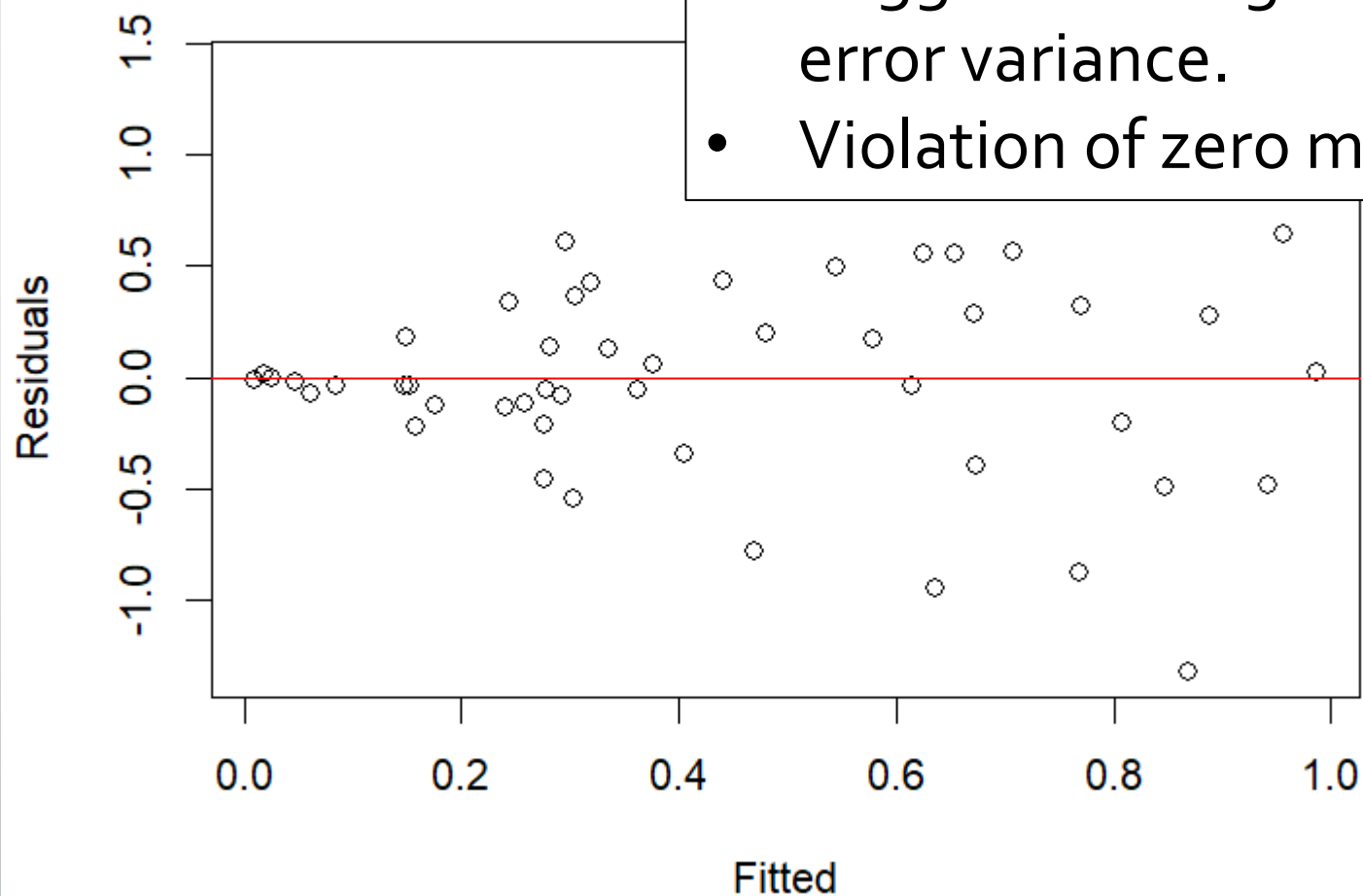
# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity

- What do you see?

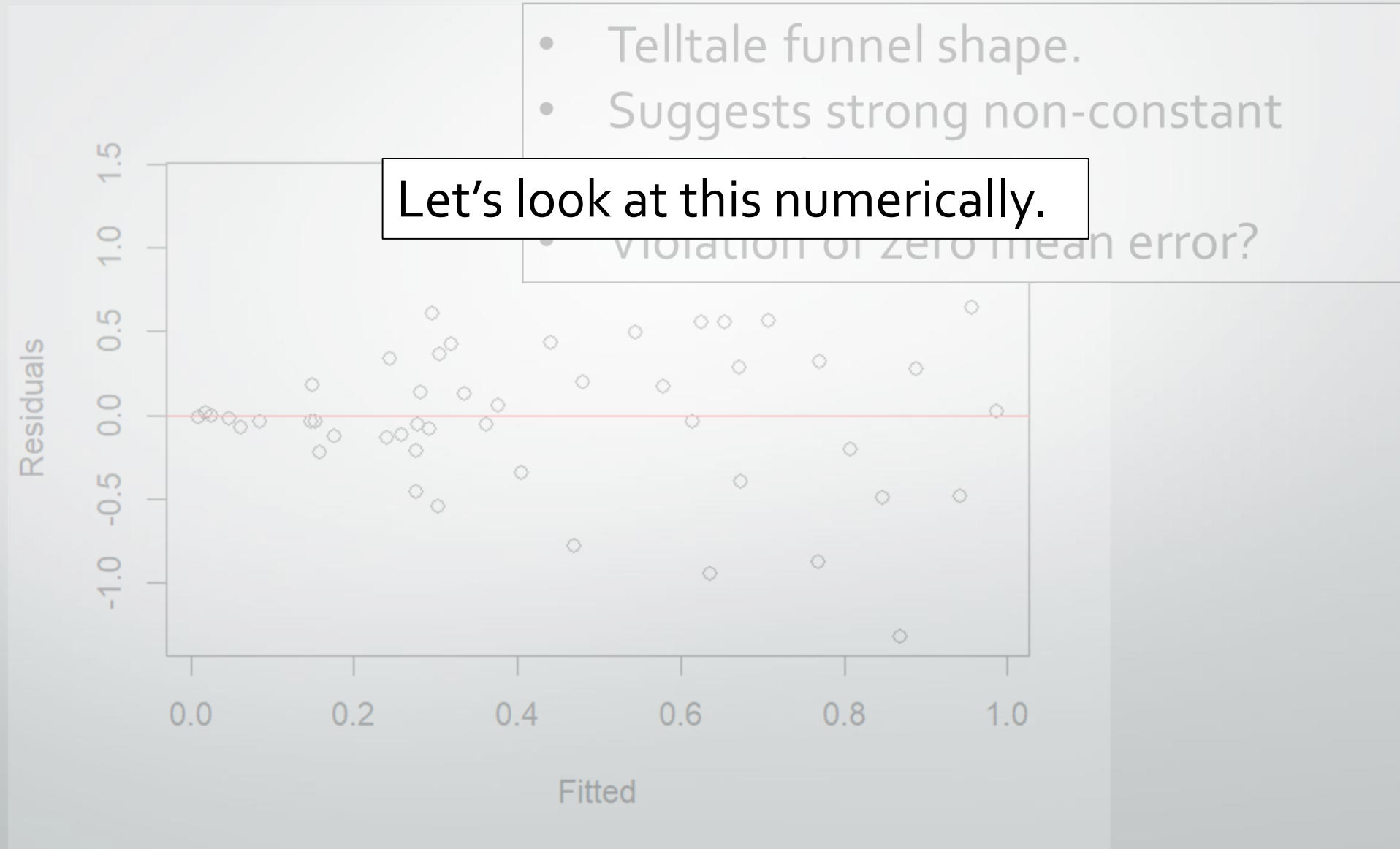


# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity

- Telltale funnel shape.
- Suggests strong non-constant error variance.
- Violation of zero mean error?



# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity



# Zero mean error - numerically

How can we assess whether the mean of our errors is 0?

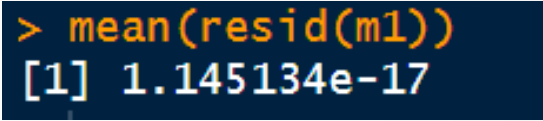
- `mean(resid(model))`

What if we wanted a p-value test whether the mean is different from 0?

- `t.test(resid(model))`
- `wilcox.test(resid(model))`

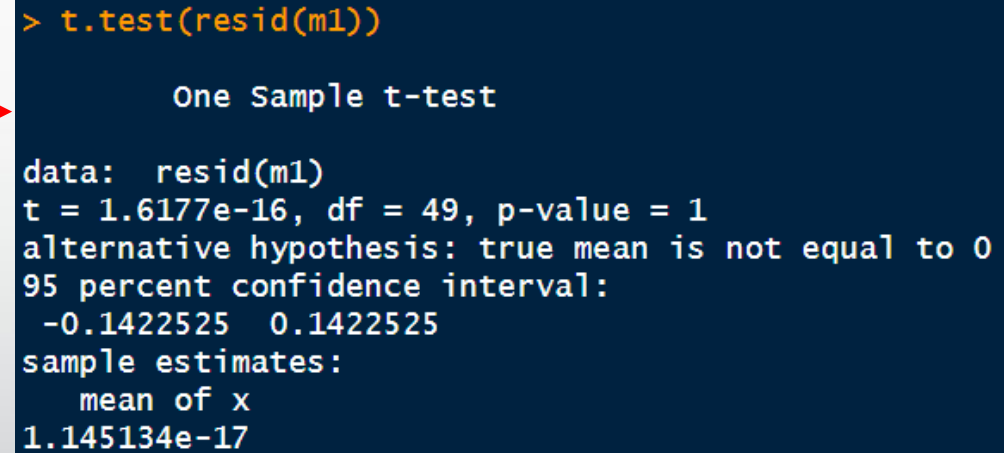
# Zero mean error - numerically

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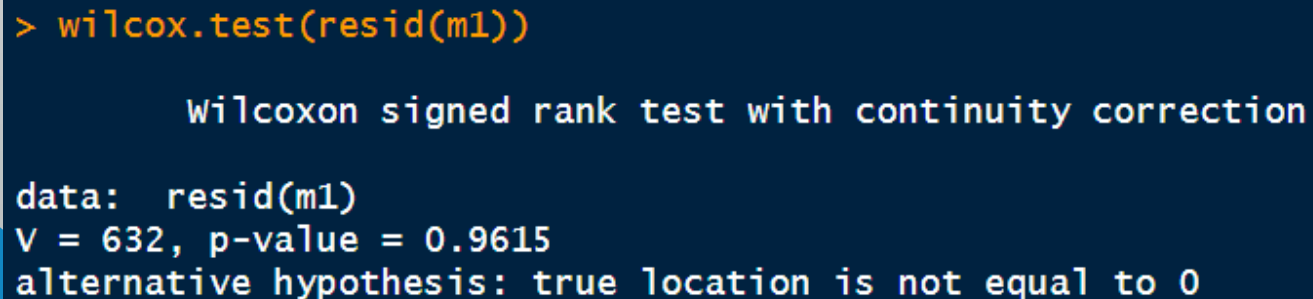
- `t.test(resid(model))` 
- `wilcox.test(resid(model))` 



```
> t.test(resid(m1))

One Sample t-test

data:  resid(m1)
t = 1.6177e-16, df = 49, p-value = 1
alternative hypothesis: true mean is not equal to 0
95 percent confidence interval:
 -0.1422525  0.1422525
sample estimates:
 mean of x
1.145134e-17
```



```
> wilcox.test(resid(m1))

Wilcoxon signed rank test with continuity correction

data:  resid(m1)
V = 632, p-value = 0.9615
alternative hypothesis: true location is not equal to 0
```

# Homoscedasticity - numerically

How can we assess whether the variance of our errors is constant?

- Partition/subset residuals and compare using F test
  - `var.test(dat$residuals[dat$fitted < 0.4], dat$residuals[dat$fitted >= 0.4])`

What else might we do?

- Examine for correlation between residuals and fitted values.
  - `cor(dat$residuals, dat$fitted)`
- Fit linear model comparing residuals and fitted values.
  - `summary(lm(residuals ~ fitted, dat))`

# Homoscedasticity - numerically

How can we assess whether the variance of our errors is constant?

- Partition/subset residuals and compare using F test
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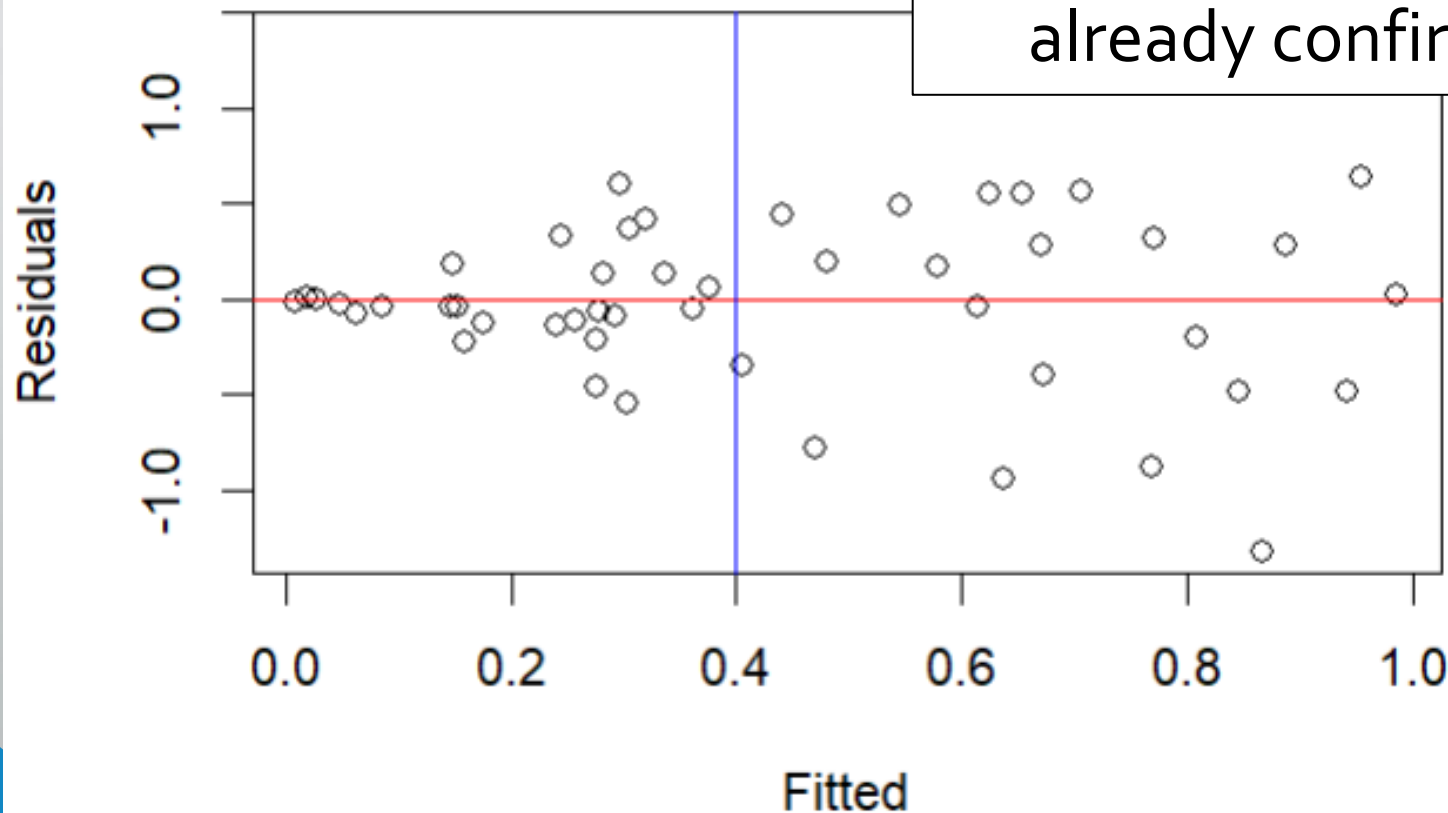
What do you expect to see with each of these tests?

What else might we do?

- Examine for correlation between residuals and fitted values.
  - `cor(dat$residuals, dat$fitted)`
- Fit linear model comparing residuals and fitted values.
  - `summary(lm(residuals ~ fitted, dat))`

# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity

- Telltale funnel shape.
- Suggests strong non-constant error variance.
- No violation of zero mean error already confirmed.





# Homoscedasticity - numerically

How can we assess whether the variance of our errors is constant?

- Partition/subset residuals and compare using F test
  - `var.test(dat$residuals[dat$fitted < 0.4],  
dat$residuals[dat$fitted >= 0.4])`

```
> var.test(dat$residuals[dat$fitted < 0.4], dat$residuals[dat$fitted >= 0.4])
```

```
F test to compare two variances
```

```
data: dat$residuals[dat$fitted < 0.4] and dat$residuals[dat$fitted >= 0.4]
```

```
F = 0.13192, num df = 25, denom df = 23, p-value = 3.744e-06
```

```
alternative hypothesis: true ratio of variances is not equal to 1
```

```
95 percent confidence interval:
```

```
0.05768073 0.29749247
```

```
sample estimates:
```

```
ratio of variances
```

```
0.1319215
```

# Homoscedasticity - numerically

How can we assess whether the variance of our errors is constant?

- Examine for correlation between residuals and fitted values.

- `cor(dat$residuals, dat$fitted)`

```
> cor(dat$fitted, dat$residuals)
[1] 0.02424518
```

- Fit linear model comparing residuals and fitted values.

- `summary(lm(residuals ~`

```
> summary(lm(residuals ~ fitted, dat))
```

Call:

```
lm(formula = residuals ~ fitted, data = dat)
```

Residuals:

| Min      | 1Q       | Median   | 3Q      | Max     |
|----------|----------|----------|---------|---------|
| -1.36993 | -0.21725 | -0.02996 | 0.26965 | 1.35893 |

Coefficients:

|             | Estimate | Std. Error | t value | Pr(> t ) |
|-------------|----------|------------|---------|----------|
| (Intercept) | 0.01052  | 0.13442    | 0.078   | 0.938    |
| fitted      | 0.04313  | 0.25668    | 0.168   | 0.867    |

Residual standard error: 0.5057 on 48 degrees of freedom

Multiple R-squared: 0.0005878, Adjusted R-squared: -0.02023

F-statistic: 0.02823 on 1 and 48 DF, p-value: 0.8673

# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity

## Zero mean error

- Can be difficult to assess graphically.
- Better to assess by taking mean of the residuals → can get p-value if needed.

## Homoscedasticity

- Should **always** assess graphically.
- For less obvious cases can stratify errors and compare variance of strata using F test.
- Checking correlation/association between residuals and fitted values generally insufficient.

# Zero mean error + homoscedasticity

Zero mean

- Can be d
- Better to needed.

Homosce

- Should a
- For less c strata us
- Checking generally

There are a number of other tests that you may come across which aim to assess homoscedasticity (e.g., Levene, Brown-Forsythe, Breusch-Pagan, Bartlett).

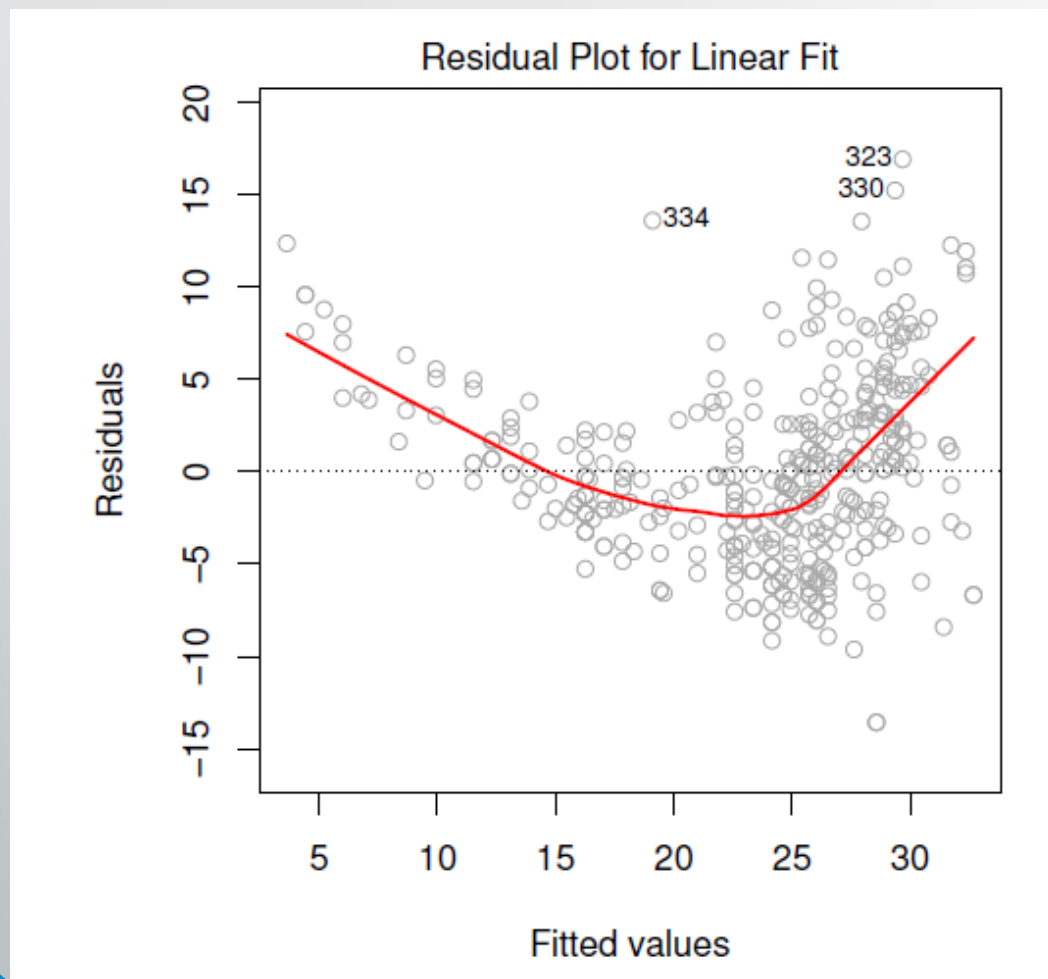
**\*\*Do not use these in this class. Each has its own limitations which we will not go into, so stick with the approaches we've discussed.\*\***

et p-value if

ariance of

fitted values

# Zero mean error + error normality



Can clearly see that the residuals are not normally distributed.

ISLR Figure 3.9

# How else might we assess error normality?

- Graphically?
- Statistically?

# How else might we assess error normality?

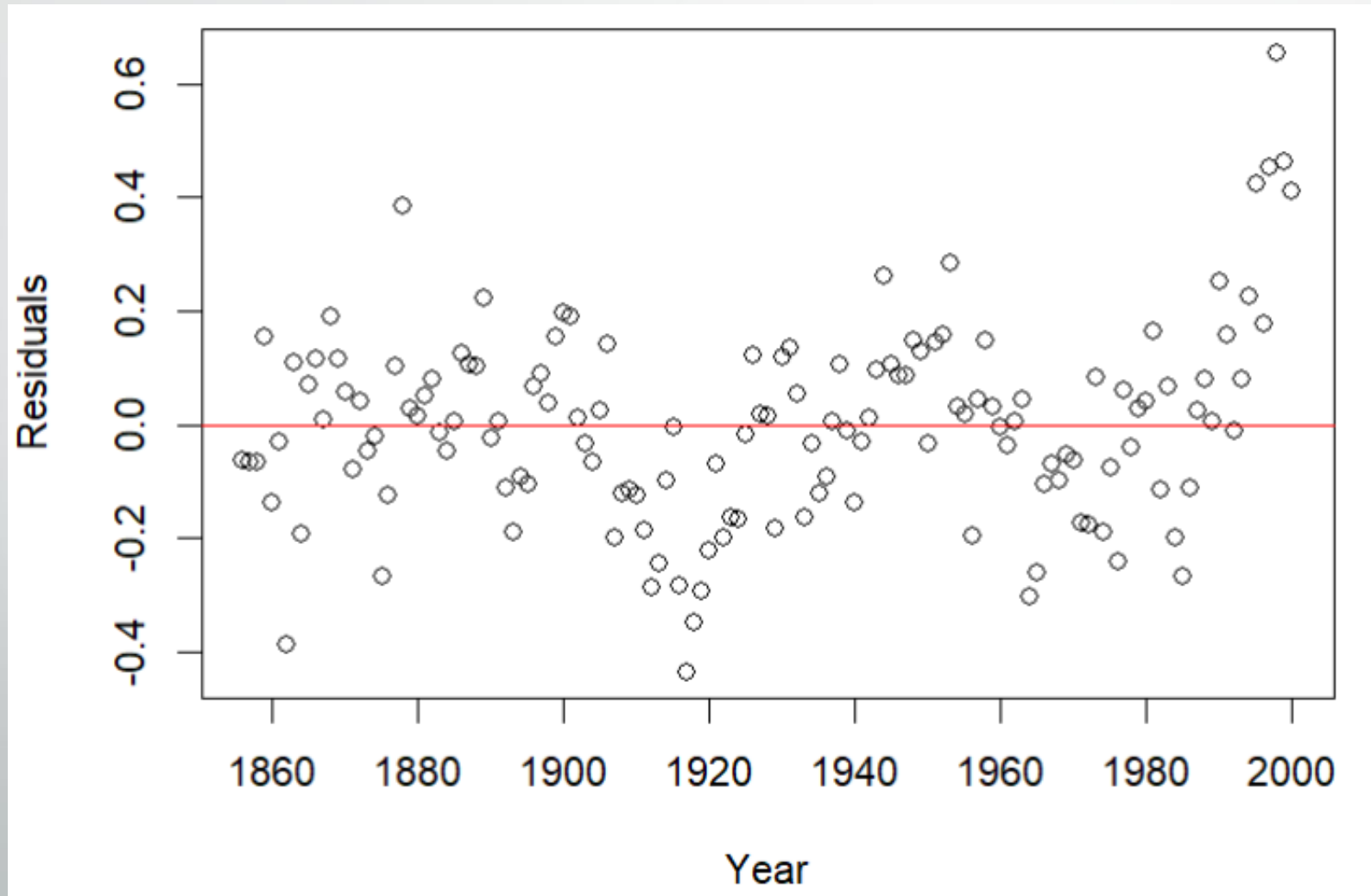
- Graphically?
  - QQ plot
- Statistically?
  - Shapiro-Wilk test
  - Should not be relied on as it may suggest departures from normality when there really are none—particularly with large sample sizes.

# Uncorrelated errors

- One of the most important assumptions to assess, but unfortunately also difficult to assess given the numerous patterns correlation can take.
- Some common examples when errors may be correlated:
  - Time series data: (e.g., temperature over time, cases of influenza over time, etc.)
  - Clustered data: (e.g., geographic proximity, repeated measures, etc.)
- Serial correlation like that seen in time series data can sometimes be identified using residual plots.
  - Often, the potential for correlated errors is something you need to consider when assessing the type of data you're using.



# Uncorrelated errors





Unusual observations

# Unusual observations

## Leverage

- How similar the value of an observation is in relation to the majority of values for that variable.

## Outliers

- How similar is an observation compared to what the regression estimates for that value.

## Influential points

- Removal of an influential observation from the data results in a large change in the model fit.

# Unusual observations

## Leverage

- Measured with hat and internally studentized residuals
  - `hatvalues(model)` → should sum to number of parameters in model
    - Want to examine hat values  $> 2(\text{mean}(\text{hatvalues}(\text{model})))$
    - Larger hat value → greater leverage (often examined using half normal plot)
  - `rstandard(model)`

## Outliers

- Measured through externally studentized residuals – `rstudent()`
  - Can assess whether largest residuals are greater than the critical value by:
    - `sort(abs(r_ex), dec=T)[1:10] > abs(qt(.05/(10), 120-2))`

## Influential points

- Measured with Cook's Distance – `cooks.distance(model)`

# Unusual observations

## Leverage

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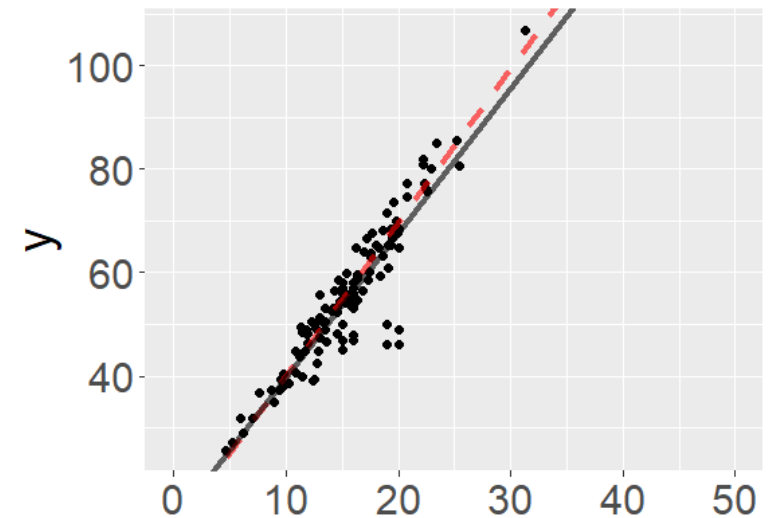
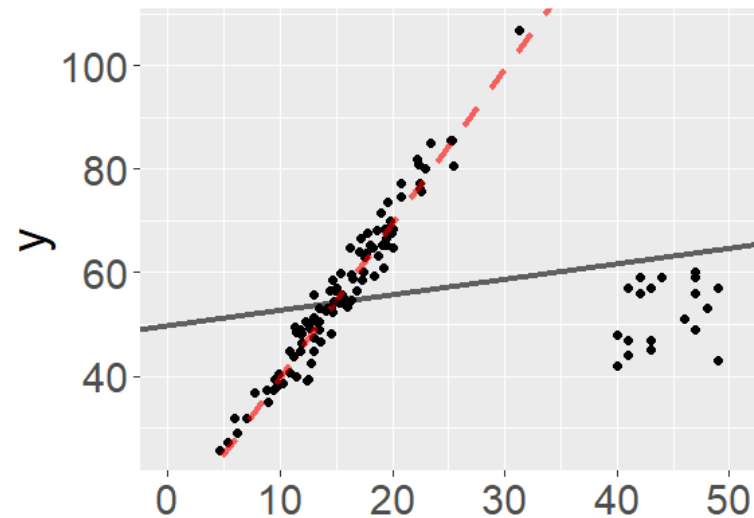
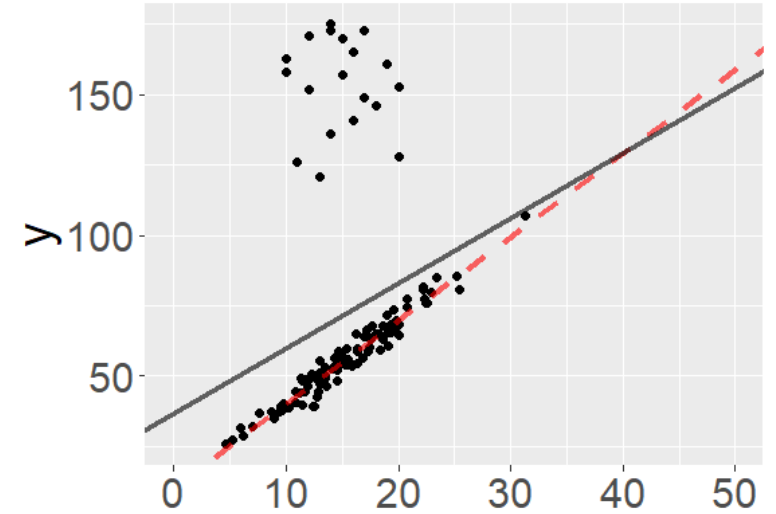
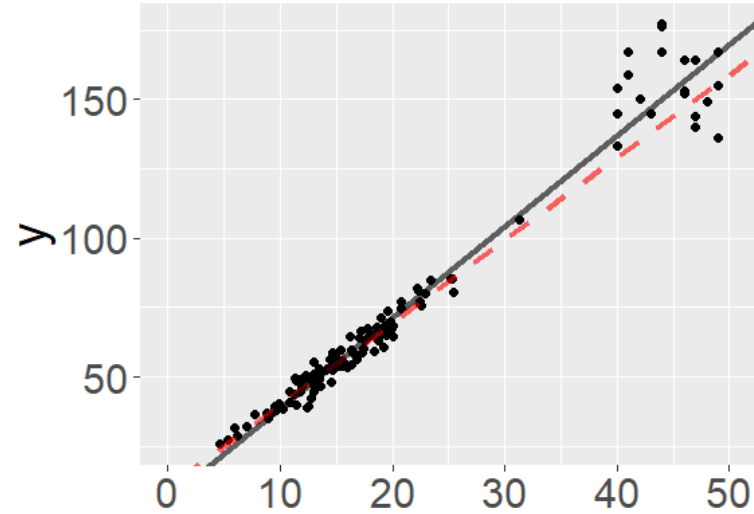
- Measured with Cook's Distance – `cooks.distance(model)`

# Perfect\_add2-perfect\_add5 Models

What do you points  
do you think have  
high leverage?

Are outliers?

Are influential?





Multiple testing

# Multiple testing

- We saw the code below a few slides ago. Where is the correction for multiple testing?
  - `sort(abs(r_ex), dec=T)[1:10] > abs(qt(.05/(10), 120-2))`



# Multiple testing

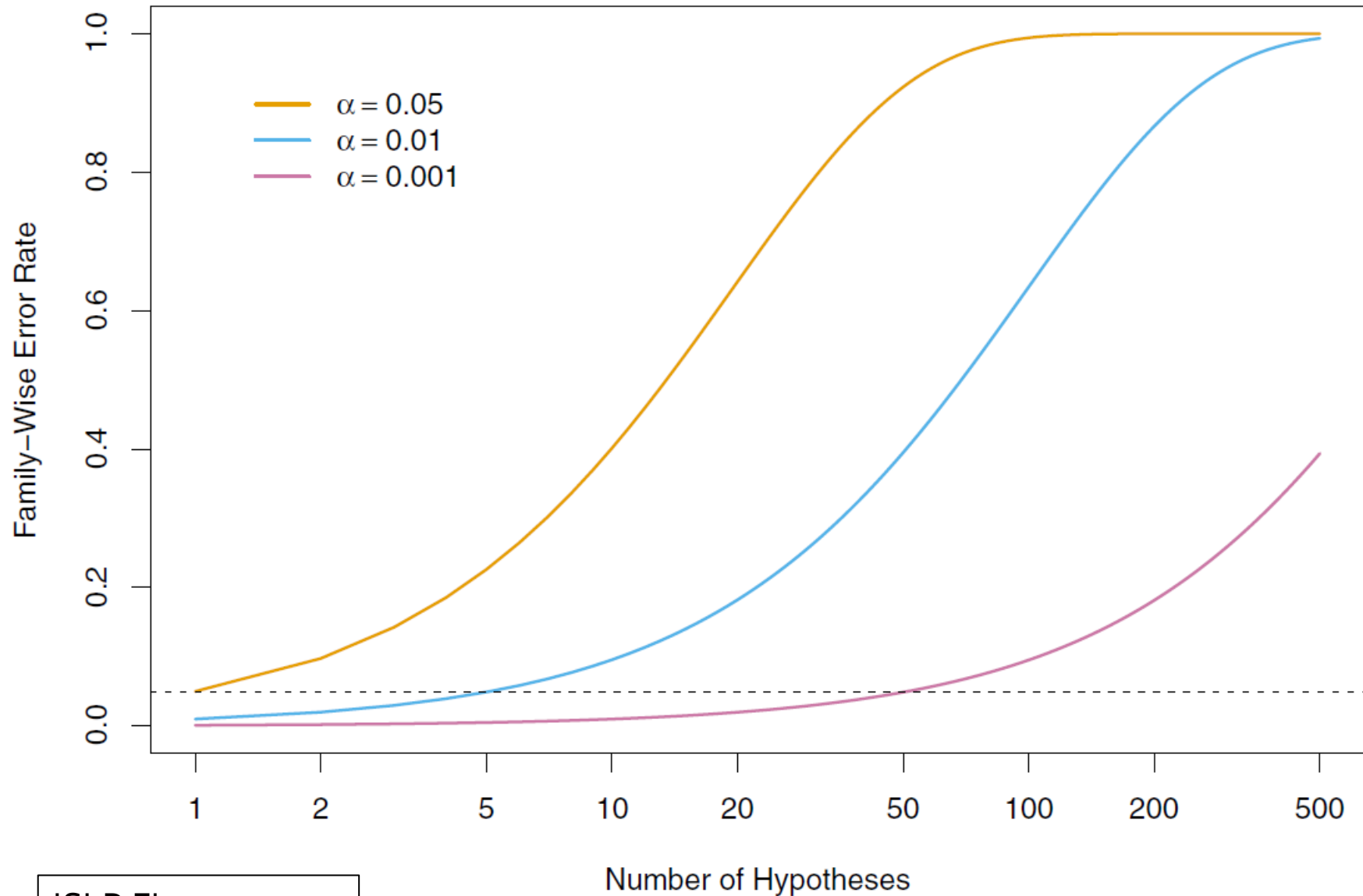
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# Multiple testing

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- We're making 10 comparisons, so under the Bonferroni correction we divide alpha by 10.

What does this do?

# Multiple testing



ISLR Figure 13.2